

Software Requirements Specification for a Collaboration Platform for Project Studies

Report for Project Study

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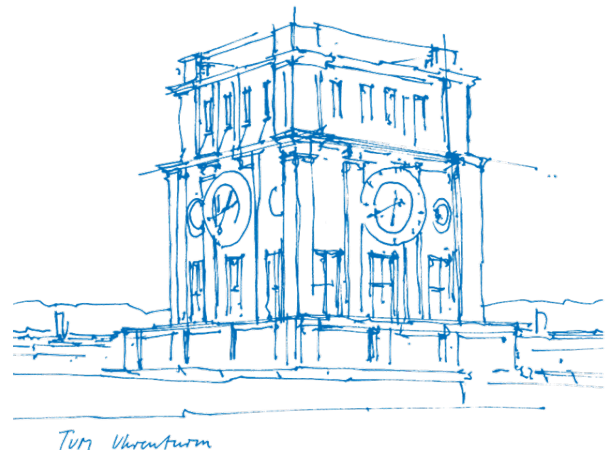
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1. Introduction

1.1. Purpose of this Document

1.2. Project Background and Motivation

1.3. Scope of the Platform

1.4. Definitions, Acronyms, and Abbreviations

1.5. Document Overview

2. Literature review

In this section we review the academic grounding for the project's methodological choices. In particular, the requirements engineering approach and the broader phenomenon of academia-industry collaboration that the platform aims to address.

2.1. Requirements Engineering Grounding

2.1.1. Selection and Adaptation of the Requirements Engineering Standard

This specification follows ISO/IEC/IEEE 29148:2018 (Society, 2018) – the current international standard for requirements engineering, which supersedes IEEE 830-1998 (Society, 1998). The predecessor addressed the specification document alone, whereas 29148 covers the requirements process as a whole, including elicitation, analysis and validation. Consequently, such a form is more appropriate for this project, since much of what follows concerns how requirements were derived from stakeholder interviews and how strongly each is supported. The standard is applied in scaled-down form appropriate to a single-semester project and extended with a literature review section to meet the academic requirements of a project study report.

2.1.2. Interview-Based Requirements Elicitation

Semi-structured interviews were used to explore stakeholder needs without assuming pre-defined system requirements. Ferrari et al. (2022) show that interviews support an iterative elicitation process in which stakeholder initial ideas are progressively clarified and refined into requirements through the dialogue and iterative feedback. Accordingly, this project first analyzed interview data inductively to identify recurring needs and pain points, which then served as the basis for deriving platform requirements.

2.1.3. Sample Adequacy and Thematic Saturation

MacQueen et al. (1998) defined thematic saturation as the point at which no new codes emerge from additional interviews. And, the number of interviews required to reach the point of saturation is a recurring question in qualitative research.

Guest et al. (2006) found that little new information emerged after the first 12 of their 60 interviews.

Hennink et al. (2017) argue that the answer depends on what saturation is taken to mean. No new codes appeared in their data after 9 interviews, but arriving at a rich understanding of those codes took between 16 and 24. These figures come from fairly uniform groups of participants.

Hagaman & Wutich (2017) worked across 4 sites and found that 16 interviews or fewer sufficed within a single group, while themes running across groups needed 20 to 40.

These thresholds provide a basis for assessing the 26 interviews conducted for this study rather than merely reporting their number. The student group, at 13 interviews, exceeds the code-saturation threshold reported by Hennink et al. and falls within the range Hagaman and Wutich associate with thematic convergence in a single group; the pain points reported for students in Section 5.1 can therefore be regarded as reasonably stable. The company, professor and university-staff groups, at 5, 6 and 2 interviews respectively, fall below every threshold cited above, and findings specific to them are correspondingly treated as indicative. The cross-cutting findings in Section 5.4, which draw on the full sample of 26, sit within the range associated with cross-group themes, though not at its upper end. Requirements are accordingly framed throughout as informed proposals rather than validated findings.

2.1.4. Requirements Traceability

Requirements traceability is the ability to follow a requirement forward into design and implementation and backward to the source it came from. Gotel & Finkelstein (1994), drawing on interviews and questionnaires with over 100 practitioners, distinguish these two directions and argue that the backward one is where projects usually fail.

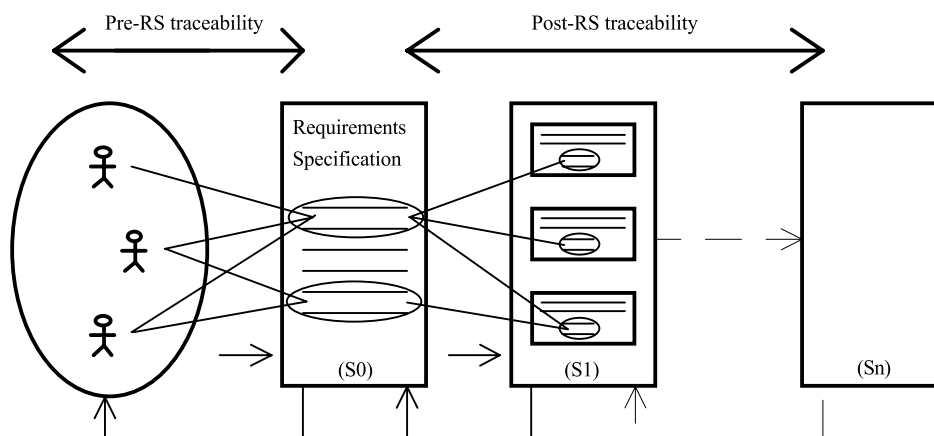


Figure 1: Illustration of the two directions of requirements traceability from Gotel & Finkelstein (1994)

Post-specification traceability, linking requirements to what was built from them, is comparatively well supported by tools. Pre-specification traceability, linking a requirement back to the stakeholder statement and rationale that produced it, tends to be neglected, and most of the problems attributed to poor traceability turn out to originate there.

Section 9 is organised along both directions: Section 9.1 provides the pre-specification record, tracing each requirement back to its pain point and interview material, while Section 9.2 and 9.3 provide the post-specification record, mapping requirements forward to prototype screens and accounting for those left unimplemented.

2.1.5. Requirements Prioritization

Prioritization techniques differ mainly in how much they demand of the team using them. Reviewing the field, Achimugu et al. (2014) find that pairwise methods such as the Analytic Hierarchy Process become impractical as requirement counts grow, and that cost-value approaches depend on effort and benefit estimates unavailable at this stage of a project. MoSCoW asks for neither, sorting requirements into four ordinal classes on judgement alone, which suits a small team working to a fixed deadline on requirements that have not been validated. The criteria used for that sorting are set out in Section 6.1.

2.2. Academia-Industry Collaboration

2.2.1. Collaboration friction as an established phenomenon

Collaboration between universities and companies has been studied extensively, and the difficulties it produces are documented rather than incidental. Ankrah & AL-Tabbaa (2015) synthesise a fragmented body of work into a process framework covering why the two sides collaborate, the forms collaboration takes, and the organisational obstacles that recur across national contexts. Coordination and communication problems appear throughout that literature, independent of country, discipline and collaboration format. Since this problem is documented across many institutions, the difficulties reported in Section 5 are treated as a specific case of it rather than as a local peculiarity.

2.2.2. Barriers and information asymmetry between stakeholder groups

Bruneel et al. (2010) separate two kinds of barrier to university-industry collaboration. Orientation-related barriers arise from differences in what each side is trying to achieve and on what timescale. Transaction-related barriers arise from the mechanics of working together, including administration and intellectual property. Prior collaboration experience reduces the first kind, while trust between the parties reduces both. Difficulties such as identifying the right contact person or establishing what expertise is available fall into the second category, which is where a platform can plausibly intervene. This distinction is used in Section 5.4 to organise the pain points that recur across stakeholder groups.

2.2.3. Divergent motivations of academic and industry partners

The two sides enter collaboration for different reasons. Perkmann et al. (2013) show that academic engagement is driven largely by research-related motives, including access to data, funding and problems worth studying, while firms pursue capability, talent and commercial application. Neither set of motives is illegitimate, but they are not automatically aligned, and the semester rhythm that governs university work rarely matches company project timelines. A platform mediating between the two therefore cannot assume a shared

objective; it has to make each side's constraints legible to the other. Section 5.4 returns to this point where the mismatch surfaced in the interview data.

2.2.4. Platforms and intermediaries as a category of solution

Where two parties struggle to find and evaluate each other, a third party can lower the cost of doing so. Howells (2006) develops a typology of innovation intermediaries and defines them as bodies acting as brokers between parties in the innovation process, performing functions such as scanning, matchmaking and coordination. The platform specified in this document sits in that category, with the difference that it serves three groups rather than two.

3. Research Approach and Limitations

3.1. Interview Methodology

The study followed a sequential design. The requirements engineering literature reviewed in Section 2.1 informed the interview guide, and a scoping discussion with BirdVision fixed what the client needed from the study. Stakeholder groups were then defined, participants recruited and interviews conducted. Responses were consolidated into a single matrix, analysed by group, and translated into requirements, from which the prototype, the traceability table, the use case diagrams and the key user flows were produced.

Interviews were semi-structured, using a common guide across all groups so that responses stayed comparable, with follow-up questions free to depart from it wherever a participant raised something unanticipated. The guide covered four areas:

1. **Current collaboration experience** — what forms of collaboration the participant had taken part in, and how they found them.
2. **Motivation** — what makes collaboration worth entering, and what makes a project attractive.
3. **Problems and barriers** — what goes wrong during collaboration, and what prevents people from engaging at all.
4. **Platform and solution needs** — asked last, so that earlier answers were not framed around a software solution.

Only the last area concerns the platform directly. The first three establish how collaboration currently works and why it is difficult, and are reported in Section 5 independently of the specification.

Four stakeholder groups were distinguished: students, companies, professors and university staff. Staff were separated from professors because their role is administrative rather than academic, and their pain points proved to differ accordingly. Participants were recruited through campus contacts and, for most company representatives, at Career Factory; Section 3.2 discusses the resulting composition and limitations.

Responses were recorded in a matrix with participants as columns and the four areas as rows, allowing each theme to be read across all participants and across groups. Section 3.3 describes how the requirements were derived from it.

3.2. Sample Composition and Limitations

Twenty-six semi-structured interviews were conducted across four stakeholder groups. Appendix B lists all participants; the distribution is summarised below.

Group	n	Institutional background
Students	13	9 TUM Heilbronn, 2 TUM Garching, 1 RWTH Aachen, 1 Reutlingen
Companies	5	Startup, industrial manufacturing, software, energy management, IT services
Professors and researchers	6	2 TUM Heilbronn, 1 TUM Munich, 1 RWTH Aachen, 1 Koblenz, 1 Passau
University staff	2	2 TUM Heilbronn

Table 1: Interview sample by stakeholder group

The sample spans five universities. Eight of the 21 university-affiliated participants are based outside TUM Campus Heilbronn, so where the same difficulties recur across institutions, they are unlikely to be local artefacts.

Two limitations shape how the company findings should be read. Most company representatives were recruited at Career Factory, a university–company event on the Bildungscampus, so the sample includes no firms that have never collaborated with a university or have stopped doing so. More importantly, four of the five hold roles in human resources, apprenticeship management or campus relations. Their interest in the university is oriented towards recruiting, and the requirements derived from this group reflect that. Needs around research cooperation, confidentiality and intellectual property are under-represented. The founder interviewed as C1 offers a partial counterweight, having neither a recruiting function nor an employer-branding budget, and is treated in Section 6 as a contrasting case rather than as one observation among five.

The company, professor and staff groups are small, and findings specific to them are treated as indicative. The staff group is smallest at two, though both are the administrators who currently run the project-study process at TUM Campus Heilbronn, so the group covers the relevant population rather than a sample of it.

This background of existing engagement is unevenly distributed across the sample. Several students and professors interviewed had no established route into university–industry collaboration, so their accounts include the perspective of those outside it. All five company representatives, by contrast, were already engaged with universities at the time of the interview. The company data therefore describes how engagement works for firms that have already committed to it, and says little about what would bring in a firm that has not.

3.3. From Interview Insights to Requirements (how findings were translated, requirements framed as informed proposals, not validated findings)

The analysis started from the response matrix described above. Each theme was read across all 26 participants, first within a stakeholder group and then across groups, and recurring statements were grouped into pain points. Pain points named by only one group are reported under that group in Section 5, while those raised by more than one group are reported once among the cross-cutting findings at the end of that section. Each pain point lists the participants who raised it, so a reader can see how many independent sources stand behind it.

Requirements were then derived from these pain points. The two sets do not match one to one. Some pain points lie outside what a platform can fix, and those are accounted for in Section 9. Some requirements, in turn, come from elsewhere. Each requirement therefore states what kind of evidence it rests on:

Basis	Meaning
Interview	Taken from one or more interview statements, cited by participant ID.
Process documentation	Taken from how the project-study process currently works at TUM Campus Heilbronn, rather than from interview data.
Design decision	A choice made by the authors, where neither source supplied a requirement. Listed individually, with reasons, in Section 10.

Table 2: Evidence basis recorded for each requirement

Two further attributes are recorded and feed the prioritization scheme in Section 6: whether the underlying pain point recurs across groups, and whether the requirement depends on TUM's administrative arrangements or would apply at any university.

The prototype was built from the requirement set as a whole rather than requirement by requirement. The mapping from requirement to screen in Section 9 was therefore drawn up after implementation, not before it.

Two limits follow. The requirements were never taken back to participants for confirmation, and the step from interview statement to pain point rests on the authors' reading of the material. Together with the sample limitations described above, this is why the requirements in Sections 6 and 7 are presented as informed proposals. Each one can be

traced to its evidence, and the strength of that evidence is recorded, but none has been checked against the people it came from.

4. Overall Description

4.1. Product Perspective

4.2. Stakeholder Groups, Roles and Motivations (students, professors/supervisors, companies)

4.3. Assumptions and Constraints

4.4. Scope Boundary: TUM-Specific Focus (explicit justification: administrative/collaboration processes differ significantly across universities, so single-institution depth was prioritized over shallow generality)

4.5. Transferability to Other Institutions (brief discussion of what would need to adapt for other universities)

4.6. Out-of-Scope Items (e.g. backend functionality not prototyped)

5. Stakeholder Needs (Pain Points)

5.1. Student Pain Points

5.1.1. Discoverability

Students consistently report that there is no clear, centralized listing for company projects. Project opportunities are described as scattered across fragmented institute websites or buried in static job boards (S6, S7, S8).

5.1.2. Missing or insufficient listing information

Project information about workload, technical requirements, deliverables, and whether the company genuinely prioritizes the project's outcome is frequently unavailable before applying (S8, S9). Company name, expected outcomes, and required skills were independently named as the minimum information needed to make an informed decision (S7, S9).

5.1.3. Communication and responsiveness

Slow communication loops and vague project scope were named as reasons a student would abandon an application outright (S8). Separately, students report response delays during the application process and a lack of feedback following rejection (S12, S13).

5.1.4. Language barrier

German-language requirements were named as a disadvantage for international students on multiple, independent occasions (S5, S7, S10).

5.1.5. Team formation

A student named the inability to find a team as something that would stop them from applying altogether, and separately requested an automated team-matching feature (S10).

5.1.6. Application process friction

One student described having to repeatedly re-enter the same information across each company's own application platform, alongside generic, under-informed initial screening and a lack of feedback after rejection (S1). A separate student reported that project details were withheld pre-NDA, leading to a fundamentally different understanding of the task once disclosed (S9)

5.1.7. Value and goal alignment

Several students indicated they would disengage from a project perceived as serving only the company's commercial interest without genuine educational or research value (S6, S8). This pattern recurs across other stakeholder groups and is developed further in Section 5.4.

5.2. Professor/University Pain Points

5.2.1. Information standardization

Professors report that companies frequently fail to provide sufficiently detailed project briefs, desired area of expertise, objective, and data availability, leaving task scope unclear for both supervisor and student (P3, P4, P6).

5.2.2. Contact and coordination burden

Locating appropriate contacts and coordinating a collaboration was named as time-consuming and requiring substantial advance planning (P1). On the administrative side, obtaining a timely response from professorships regarding supervision requests was named as the primary obstacle encountered by university staff coordinating intake (U1, U2).

5.2.3. Students' engagement with supervisors during the project

One professor observed that students frequently under-communicate with their academic supervisor once a company relationship is underway, directly linking this to reduced outcome quality, and has introduced mandatory monthly check-ins as an informal mitigation (P4).

5.2.4. Outcome measurement

Two different professors reported that there is no formal mechanism for assessing whether the effort invested in a project study was proportionate to its value. One describes this as entirely unmeasured, the other as narrative rather than KPI-based (P1, P5). This pattern recurs in Section 5.4.

5.2.5. Resource pressure

Time and financial resources dedicated to these collaborations were named as the first budget item companies tend to cut, constraining the professor's ability to sustain partnerships (P5).

5.3. Company Pain Points

5.3.1. Contact identification and structural complexity

Identifying the correct contact person and aligning expectations, timelines, and available resources was the most frequently cited difficulty (C3, C4). University structures were separately described as complex and inconsistent between institutions (C4), directly reinforcing the transferability discussion in Section 4.4-4.5.

5.3.2. Missing information when searching for partners

Companies report a lack of visibility into contact details, areas of expertise, ongoing projects, and collaboration opportunities (C4), as well as the absence of a clear overview of available posting/collaboration options (C5).

5.3.3. Output quality and delivery friction

For one company, the central concern was not access to universities but the practical usability of delivered outcomes, compounded by software-tooling mismatches between student and company environments (C2). A second company reported an inability to assess student or study quality in advance, which discourages deeper engagement. (C5).

5.3.4. Need for trust and verification

Companies want assurance that student and professor profiles are genuinely affiliated with their stated institution, citing existing third-party verification services elsewhere as a reasonable precedent (C4).

5.3.5. Screening signal degradation

One company noted that student CVs are increasingly perceived as AI-generated and therefore less reliable as a screening tool, expressing a preference for more direct channels, including contact with student clubs, over formal university structures (C3).

5.4. Cross-Cutting Findings (pain points recurring across all three groups)

5.4.1. Contact-person and reachability breakdown

Identifying and reaching the correct person was named independently by professors (P1), companies (C3, C4), and university staff (U2, U3). It is the most broadly and heavily evidenced finding in the dataset, spanning three stakeholder groups.

5.4.2. Bidirectional information insufficiency

Every stakeholder group reports the same underlying gap directed at a different counterpart: students want more complete project information from companies and professors (S7, S9); professors want companies to provide more structured project detail (P3); companies want more visibility into student and professor profiles, expertise, and ongoing activity (C4). The specific direction differs but the pattern recurs across all three groups.

5.4.3. Academia-industry goal misalignment

This is the most substantively supported cross-cutting finding. The university research staff perspective names it directly (U1), one company frames it as their central complaint about output usability (C2), a second names it explicitly as a reason to disengage (C4), and it recurs independently across multiple students, either as a disengagement trigger (S6) or as lived experience (S8, S11).

5.4.4. Outcome quality

Two professors report no formal mechanism for evaluating whether a project study delivered proportionate value (P1, P5); this connects directly to one company's independent

complaint that project studies deliver limited usable insight (C2) and another professor's complaint that outcome quality is highly dependent on student engagement (P4).

5.4.5. Slow or unresponsive communication

Named as an application-ending concern by students (S8, S12, S13) and, from the opposite side of the same process, as staff's core administrative obstacle in obtaining professor responses (U2, U3).

6. Functional Requirements

6.1. Prioritization Scheme (MoSCoW, criteria defined here. Requirements grounded in cross-cutting pain points and structurally independent of TUM-specific administration are prioritized higher)

6.2. [Functional Area 1]

6.3. [Functional Area 2]

6.4. [Functional Area 3]

6.5. [Functional Area 4]

7. Non-Functional Requirements

7.1. Usability

7.2. Security and Data Privacy

7.3. Maintainability / Extensibility

8. System Models

8.1. Use Case Diagram(s)

8.2. Key User Flows

9. Traceability and Prototype Alignment

9.1. Traceability Table: Interview Insight → Pain Point → Requirement ID

9.2. Prototype Coverage Table: Screen → Requirement ID

9.3. Pain Points Without Requirements and Requirements Without Prototype Coverage (brief justification)

10. Assumptions, Risks, and Open Issues

11. Appendices

12. Declaration of authorship

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